

Instrumental Variables

Session 1: Foundations and Mechanics

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Empirical Methods for PhD Students

- 1 Foundations of Instrumental Variables
- 2 2SLS and Overidentification
- 3 Instrument Strength
- 4 Classic Applications: Top-5 Journal Papers
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Three Conditions for a Valid Instrument

A valid instrument Z_i must satisfy three conditions:

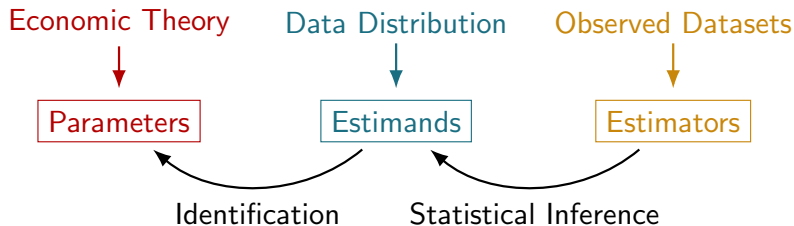
1. **Relevance (First Stage):** Z_i must be correlated with the endogenous treatment D_i
 - ▷ Testable: first-stage F-statistic (rule of thumb: $F > 10$)
2. **Independence (As-Good-As-Random Assignment):** Z_i must be uncorrelated with unobserved confounders ε_i
 - ▷ Not directly testable; requires economic reasoning and robustness checks
3. **Exclusion Restriction:** Z_i affects outcome Y_i *only* through its effect on D_i
 - ▷ No direct effect; testable indirectly via placebo/falsification

In Session 2 we add a 4th condition: **Monotonicity** (for the LATE interpretation).

Three distinct objects, not always clearly distinguished:

- **Parameters** come from economic (or other) models of the world
 - ▷ E.g. a potential-outcome model relating schooling to earnings
 - ▷ They set the *target* for empirical analyses: what we want to know
- **Estimands** are functions of the population data distribution
 - ▷ E.g. a difference in means or ratio of population regression coefficients
 - ▷ Identification: assumptions that link parameters to estimands
- **Estimators** are functions of observed (sample) data
 - ▷ E.g. a sample ratio of OLS coefficients
 - ▷ Estimators are random variables; statistical inference studies their distribution

The Lay of the Land



Separating identification (linking parameters to estimands) from inference (linking estimators to estimands) keeps the analysis disciplined.

The Endogeneity Problem

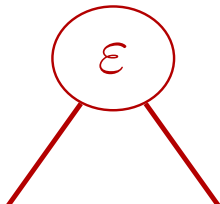
Simple causal model: $Y_i = \beta D_i + \varepsilon_i$, where D_i is the treatment, ε_i is the unobserved term.

In large samples, OLS converges to:

$$\beta^{OLS} = \beta + \frac{Cov(\varepsilon_i, D_i)}{Var(D_i)}$$

- OLS identifies β *only if* $Cov(\varepsilon_i, D_i) = 0$
- **Selection bias:** units with higher/lower ε_i select into treatment, so $Cov(\varepsilon_i, D_i) \neq 0$

Causal diagram:



The IV Solution

Suppose $Z_i \in \{0, 1\}$ is a binary instrument (e.g. lottery assignment).

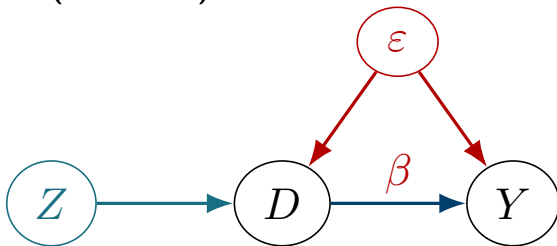
- **Randomness:** $Cov(Z_i, \varepsilon_i) = 0$ (no direct link to unobservables)
- **Exclusion:** Z_i affects Y_i only through D_i

Plugging in $\varepsilon_i = Y_i - \beta D_i$:

$$Cov(Z_i, Y_i - \beta D_i) = 0 \implies \beta = \frac{Cov(Z_i, Y_i)}{Cov(Z_i, D_i)} \equiv \beta^{IV},$$

so long as $Cov(Z_i, D_i) \neq 0$ (relevance).

Causal diagram (IV adds Z):



No arrow from Z to ε (independence) and no arrow from Z to Y

A simple decomposition links IV back to familiar OLS regressions:

$$\beta^{IV} = \frac{Cov(Z_i, Y_i)}{Cov(Z_i, D_i)} = \frac{Cov(Z_i, Y_i)/Var(Z_i)}{Cov(Z_i, D_i)/Var(Z_i)} \equiv \frac{\rho}{\pi}$$

where ρ and π come from two OLS regressions:

$$Y_i = \kappa + \rho Z_i + \nu_i \quad (\text{"reduced form"})$$

$$D_i = \mu + \pi Z_i + \eta_i \quad (\text{"first stage"})$$

- The **first stage** shows how strongly Z_i moves D_i
- The **reduced form** shows the net effect of Z_i on Y_i
- IV scales the reduced form by the first stage to recover β

If Z_i is as-good-as-random only *conditional* on covariates W_i , add them to both equations:

$$\begin{aligned}Y_i &= \kappa + \rho Z_i + W_i' \phi + \nu_i \\D_i &= \mu + \pi Z_i + W_i' \psi + \eta_i\end{aligned}$$

- The Frisch-Waugh-Lovell theorem tells us the effective instrument is now $\tilde{Z}_i$: the residuals from regressing Z_i on W_i
- If W_i is a set of randomization-strata dummies, $\tilde{Z}_i$ captures within-strata variation in Z_i
- Key: controls should be chosen on substantive grounds, not to maximize the first-stage F-statistic

Classic Example: Angrist (1990) Vietnam Draft Lottery

Angrist (1990, AER) estimated the earnings effect of military service using Vietnam-era draft-eligibility as an instrument.

- $Z_i \in \{0, 1\}$: randomly assigned draft eligibility (lottery number)
- $D_i \in \{0, 1\}$: actual military service
- Y_i : later-life earnings

With binary Z_i , the IV estimand simplifies to the **Wald estimand**:

$$\beta^{IV} = \frac{E[Y_i \mid Z_i = 1] - E[Y_i \mid Z_i = 0]}{E[D_i \mid Z_i = 1] - E[D_i \mid Z_i = 0]}$$

- Numerator: earnings effect of draft eligibility (reduced form)
- Denominator: effect of eligibility on actual service probability (first stage)
- Finding: military service reduces early-career earnings by $\approx 15\%$

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When $\dim(Z_i) = L > J = \dim(X_i)$, the system is *overidentified*:

$$\text{Cov}(\tilde{Z}_i, Y_i - X_i' \beta) = 0 \implies \underbrace{\text{Cov}(\tilde{Z}_i, Y_i)}_{L \times 1} = \underbrace{\text{Cov}(\tilde{Z}_i, X_i')}_{L \times J} \underbrace{\beta}_{J \times 1}$$

- We have more moment conditions than parameters
- Any full-rank $J \times L$ matrix M gives a valid IV estimator:
 $\beta^{IV}(M) = (M \text{Cov}(\tilde{Z}_i, X_i'))^{-1} M \text{Cov}(\tilde{Z}_i, Y_i)$
- Choice of M trades off efficiency vs. interpretability

Two-Stage Least Squares (2SLS)

2SLS chooses $M' = \pi$ (the matrix of first-stage coefficients):

- Effective instrument: $\tilde{Z}_i^* = \tilde{Z}_i' \pi$ (residualized first-stage fitted values)
- Combine instruments according to their predictive power for $X_i \Rightarrow$ minimizes the 2SLS standard error

Two-stage interpretation:

1. *First stage*: regress X_i on Z_i and W_i ; save fitted values $\hat{X}_i$
2. *Second stage*: regress Y_i on $\hat{X}_i$ and W_i

Practical warning

Never run 2SLS by hand—the second-stage standard errors are wrong. Use `ivreg2` (Stata) or `AER::ivreg()` / `fixest::feols()` (R).

2SLS as a Weighted Average of Just-Identified IVs

When there is a single treatment ($J = 1$), 2SLS has an elegant weighted-average representation:

$$\beta^{2SLS} = \sum_{\ell} \omega_{\ell} \beta_{\ell}^{IV}, \quad \omega_{\ell} = \frac{\pi_{\ell}^2 \text{Var}(\tilde{Z}_{i\ell})}{\sum_{\ell'} \pi_{\ell'}^2 \text{Var}(\tilde{Z}_{i\ell'})}$$

- $\beta_{\ell}^{IV} = \rho_{\ell}/\pi_{\ell}$ is the just-identified IV estimate using instrument ℓ alone
- Weights ω_{ℓ} are proportional to each instrument's contribution to first-stage variation
- Instruments with stronger first stages receive larger weights
- This “visual IV” representation (slope of ρ_{ℓ} on π_{ℓ}) is also useful for diagnosis

Under the *constant-effects* model, all just-identified IVs identify the same β :

- If β_ℓ^{IV} differ significantly across instruments, something is wrong
- The Sargan–Hansen statistic tests $H_0 : \beta_\ell^{IV} = \beta$ for all ℓ ; asymptotically $\chi^2(L - J)$ under the null

Cautions:

- Low power when individual $\hat{\beta}_\ell^{IV}$ are noisy
- Rejection does *not* tell you which instrument is invalid
- Under *heterogeneous* effects (Session 2), two valid IVs can legitimately have different estimands; the test is not interpretable
- Use the test as one input among many, not as a pass/fail criterion

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If π is small relative to its standard error, the instrument is “weak”:

- Rule of thumb: first-stage $F < 10$ signals potential weakness (Staiger and Stock, 1997)
- **Bias**: 2SLS is biased toward OLS in small samples; the bias is proportional to $1/F$ approximately
- **Size distortion**: standard confidence intervals may under-cover in finite samples

Modern guidance (Angrist and Kolesár 2022):

- In the just-identified case, 2SLS is *median-unbiased*; the SE increase tends to “cover up” the bias
- Use `weakivtest` (Stata; Montiel Olea and Pflueger 2015) for more nuanced critical values
- If F is small: consider Anderson–Rubin or JIVE as robust alternatives

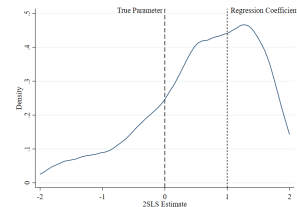
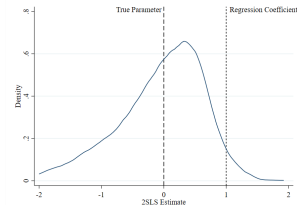
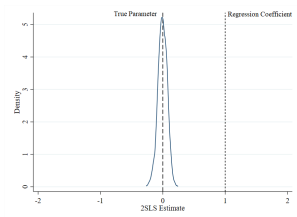
Weak Instruments: Monte Carlo

$$Y_i = 0 \cdot D_i + \varepsilon_i, D_i = \pi Z_i + \eta_i, N = 100 \text{ replications}$$

Strong ($\pi = 1, F \approx 100$)

Medium ($\pi = 0.1,$
 $F \approx 10$)

Weak ($\pi = 0.01, F \approx 1$)



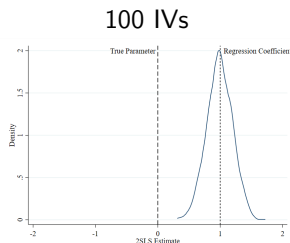
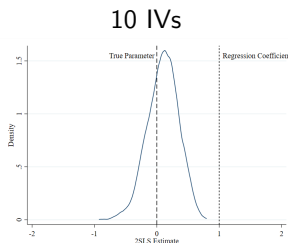
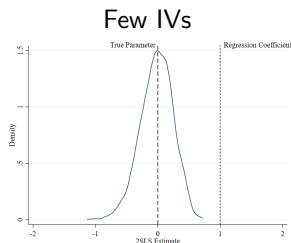
Distribution of $\hat{\beta}^{IV}$ widens dramatically as the instrument weakens. With a very weak instrument, $\hat{\beta}^{IV}$ converges to $\hat{\beta}^{OLS}$.

Many-IV Bias

Overidentified 2SLS faces an additional problem when there are many weak instruments:

- **Symptom:** low first-stage F even though SEs are small (more IVs $\Rightarrow$ richer first stage $\Rightarrow$ better fit of D_i)
- **Mechanism:** overfitting the first stage essentially recreates the endogenous variation in D_i , biasing 2SLS toward OLS
- **Historical case:** Angrist–Krueger (1991) QoB IV interacted with state $\times$ year fixed effects created hundreds of instruments

Visualized — 100 replications:



Prevention:

- Prefer parsimonious instrument sets; avoid mechanical many-IV settings
- If using a Bartik/shift-share IV with many industries, the *effective* number of instruments is the number of industries (addressed in Session 2)

Diagnosis:

- Report first-stage F-statistic (or Kleibergen–Paap for clustered SEs)
- Use `weakivtest` in Stata for heteroskedasticity-robust critical values
- See also Lee et al. (2020) for *t*-ratio-based inference

If the instrument is weak:

- Try a more informative functional form for Z_i
- Collapse to fewer instruments
- Use Anderson–Rubin confidence sets (valid regardless of strength)

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Overview: Two Landmark IV Papers (Post-2010, Top-5 Journals)

We study two highly cited papers that use creative IV designs to establish causal relationships:

1. **Nunn and Qian (2014, AER)**

“US Food Aid and Civil Conflict”

Uses US wheat production $\times$ historical aid patterns as IV. Context: Africa and developing world.

2. **Acemoglu and Restrepo (2020, JPE)**

“Robots and Employment: Evidence from US Commuting Zones”

Uses Bartik shift-share IV with robot adoption in other countries. Context: US labor markets.

Both papers were cited 1,000+ times within a decade of publication and have had substantial impact on empirical methodology.

Citation

Nunn, N. and Qian, N. (2014). “US Food Aid and Civil Conflict.” *American Economic Review*, 104(6): 1630–1666. ($\approx 1,700$ Google Scholar citations)

Research question: Does US food aid *cause* civil conflict in recipient countries?

Context & motivation:

- The US is the world's largest food-aid donor; annual shipments exceed \$1 billion
- Theoretical ambiguity: aid may reduce conflict by alleviating poverty, or *increase* conflict by providing resources to loot or by strengthening rebel groups
- OLS correlation is unreliable: countries in conflict receive more aid (*reverse causality*); unobserved factors (instability, colonial history) drive both variables (*omitted variable bias*)

The IV: Interaction of US wheat production with a country's historical propensity to receive US food aid:

$$Z_{it} = \underbrace{\text{USWheat}_t}_{\text{supply shock}} \times \underbrace{\bar{P}_i}_{\text{historical aid share}}$$

- USWheat_t : deviations in US wheat production (driven by domestic weather and farm policy, *exogenous* to recipient conditions)
- $\bar{P}_i$: fraction of years country i received US food aid in 1971–1974 (pre-determined baseline capturing structural factors: colonial ties, Cold War alignment, proximity)

Identifying variation:

- In bad US harvest years, food-aid flows fall globally
- Countries with higher historical aid propensity experience larger fluctuations—variation that is uncorrelated with their own domestic conditions

Data:

- 125 food-aid recipient countries, annual panel 1971–2006
- **Outcome:** intra-state conflict onset & incidence (from PRIO Armed Conflict Dataset)
- **Treatment:** US food aid shipments (USAID Greenbook)
- **Instrument:** USDA wheat production $\times$ historical aid share
- **Controls:** country and year fixed effects; oil prices; US GDP growth; country-specific trends

Specification:

$$\text{Conflict}_{it} = \alpha_i + \mu_t + \beta \text{FoodAid}_{it} + \mathbf{W}'_{it}\gamma + \varepsilon_{it}$$

Instrumenting FoodAid_{it} with Z_{it} via 2SLS.

Level of identifying variation: US wheat production varies year-by-year; the interaction creates country-year level variation.

Key findings:

- A 10% increase in food-aid deliveries raises the probability of civil conflict onset by ≈ 1.14 percentage points (large relative to an $\approx 5\%$ base rate)
- Effects are concentrated in countries with weak initial institutions and high ethnic fractionalization
- Stronger effects for food aid that arrives *during* conflict (suggests rebel looting mechanism)

Robustness and sensitivity:

- *Placebo crops*: using soybean or corn production instead of wheat yields near-zero first stages and insignificant reduced forms—these crops are not price-supported and less likely to drive food-aid volumes
- *Alternative instruments*: using only lagged US wheat production (dropping $\bar{P}_i$ variation) gives similar results
- *Excluding major recipients*: dropping top food-aid recipients (Egypt,

Academic contributions:

- First large- N causal evidence that food aid can increase, not decrease, conflict—a “boomerang effect”
- Shapes the debate on aid effectiveness (Easterly vs. Sachs) and humanitarian intervention design
- Demonstrates that agricultural commodity shocks in donor countries can serve as valid instruments for aid flows

IV methodology lessons:

- The **interaction instrument** $Z_{it} = \text{Shock}_t \times \text{Exposure}_i$ is a workhorse design in development economics
- Validity rests on the *supply* side (US weather/farm policy unrelated to conflict in recipient countries)
- The inclusion of country FE absorbs time-invariant confounders correlated with $\bar{P}_i$; year FE absorbs global shocks
- Always test first stage separately by sub-groups and with alternative instrument definitions

Citation

Acemoglu, D. and Restrepo, P. (2020). “Robots and Employment: Evidence from US Commuting Zones, 1990–2007.” *Journal of Political Economy*, 128(6): 2188–2244. ($\approx$ 1,800 Google Scholar citations)

Research question: What is the causal effect of industrial robot adoption on local labor markets?

Context & motivation:

- Industrial robot density rose sharply in Europe and the US from the 1990s—particularly in automotive, electronics, and metals
- Economic theory predicts robots displace routine tasks but may create complementary jobs elsewhere
- OLS is biased: industries undergoing productivity shocks may adopt robots *and* have other trends in wages/employment

The instrument: Robot adoption in other high-income countries “translated” to US commuting zones via pre-period industry shares:

$$Z_i = \sum_k \underbrace{l_{ik,1990}}_{\text{share}} \times \underbrace{\Delta \text{Robots}_{k,\text{OtherCountries}}}_{\text{shock}}$$

- **Shocks:** growth in robots per worker in industry k across Europe (France, Germany, Italy, Finland, Sweden, etc.)
- **Shares:** CZ i 's employment share in industry k as of 1990 (pre-determined)

Validity argument (parallel to ADH 2013):

- Robot adoption in European industries reflects global technology improvements, not US local demand conditions
- Pre-period shares capture industrial composition that predates the robot wave—plausibly uncorrelated with contemporaneous US labor demand shocks

Data:

- 722 US commuting zones (CZs), two periods: 1990–2007
- **Treatment:** robots per 1,000 workers in each CZ (constructed from IFR data mapped to CZ industries)
- **Outcomes:** employment-to-population ratio; log wages; share in manufacturing; hours worked
- **Instrument:** exposure to foreign robot adoption via Bartik construction above
- **Controls:** demographics, routine task intensity, CZ fixed effects, census division fixed effects

Specification:

$$\Delta Y_i = \alpha + \beta \Delta \text{Robots}_i + X_i' \gamma + \varepsilon_i$$

Instrumenting ΔRobots_i with Z_i via 2SLS across two long differences (1990–2000, 2000–2007).

Key findings:

- One additional robot per 1,000 workers $\Rightarrow$ employment ratio falls by 0.18–0.34 pp and wages by 0.25–0.5%
- Roughly 400,000–670,000 jobs displaced by robots over 1990–2007
- Effects concentrated in manufacturing; no significant offsetting job creation in other sectors
- Larger effects for lower-skill, routine-task workers

Robustness and sensitivity:

- *Pre-trend test*: robot exposure does not predict 1970–1990 employment trends (no pre-existing differences)
- *Alternative shares*: using 1970 industry shares (farther from the robot wave) gives similar results
- *Excluding auto-heavy CZs*: dropping the Midwest automotive belt does not materially change estimates
- *China competition control*: conditioning on ADH-style Chinese import competition exposure leaves robot effects intact

Academic contributions:

- Provides first rigorous causal evidence that robots reduce employment and wages—fueling the automation-inequality debate
- Methodologically pairs theory (task-based model) with credible causal identification
- Spawned a large literature on technology, automation, and labor market polarization

IV methodology lessons:

- The **Bartik shift-share** design (industry shares $\times$ global shocks) is now a standard tool in regional economics—see also Borusyak, Hull, Jaravel (2022) for formal conditions
- Foreign-country shocks are a natural exogeneity source when domestic conditions are confounded
- Pre-trend and placebo tests are essential for validating the parallel-trends implicit in share-based instruments
- SSIV formal theory and China HSR illustration are covered in

Comparing the Two Papers

	Nunn & Qian (2014)	Acemoglu & Restrepo (2020)
Journal	AER	JPE
Setting	Developing countries (Africa)	US commuting zones
Treatment	US food aid flows	Robot adoption rate
IV type	Interaction (shock $\times$ exposure)	Bartik shift-share
Exog. source	US wheat production	Foreign robot adoption
Unit	Country $\times$ year	CZ $\times$ period
Key finding	Aid $\uparrow$ conflict	Robots $\downarrow$ employment & wages
Citations	$\approx 1,700$	$\approx 1,800$

Common thread: Both exploit variation from a *different* level (global supply shocks; foreign industry adoption) that is plausibly exogenous to the unit of interest (recipient country; US commuting zone).

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IV Foundations:

- IV validity requires relevance, independence, and exclusion
- $\beta^{IV} = \rho/\pi$ (reduced form $\div$ first stage)
- With controls: effective instrument $\tilde{Z}_i = \text{residual of } Z_i \text{ on } W_i$ (Frisch–Waugh)

2SLS and Overidentification:

- 2SLS = efficiency-optimal combination of multiple instruments
- 2SLS = weighted average of just-identified IVs
- Sargan–Hansen test: diagnostic, not a “certification of validity”

Instrument Strength:

- $F > 10$ rule of thumb; `weakivtest` for robust critical values
- Many-IV bias: overfitting first stage recreates endogeneity

Applications (Top-5, Post-2010):

- Nunn & Qian (2014, AER): food aid $\Rightarrow$ conflict using interaction IV
- Acemoglu & Restrepo (2020, IPE): robots $\Rightarrow$ employment loss

1. IV Interpretation (LATE)

- ▶ Imbens–Angrist (1994) assumptions: monotonicity, compliers
- ▶ Characterizing compliers; diff-in-diff IV

2. Formula Instruments

- ▶ Shift-share IV: formal conditions (Borusyak et al. 2022)
- ▶ Recentered IV: beyond shift-share (Borusyak and Hull 2023)
- ▶ Illustration: China High-Speed Rail market access

3. IV with Chinese Economic Context

- ▶ Meng, Qian, Yared (2015, *ReStud*): Great Famine IV
- ▶ Khandelwal, Schott, Wei (2013, *QJE*): WTO quota removal

Instrumental Variables — Session 1

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Questions welcome via email.

Session 2 slides cover IV interpretation and Chinese applications.